

Chapter 6: Preparation of Small-Molecule Libraries

Elvis Martis

March 21, 2026

1 Introduction

Small molecules that bind receptors are called ligands. Although the terms *ligand* and *drug* are sometimes used interchangeably, it is important to recognise that while all drugs are ligands, not all ligands qualify as drugs. Ligands are typically represented initially as 2D atomic connectivity graphs. These representations are converted into 3D structures and subjected to energy minimisation before molecular docking simulations. When screening large chemical libraries, often comprising millions or even billions of compounds, an initial filtering stage is commonly applied to enrich for molecules with drug-like properties. This process typically involves evaluating physicochemical descriptors such as molecular weight, lipophilicity ($\log P$), the number of rotatable bonds, and the counts of hydrogen bond donors and acceptors. One of the most widely applied guidelines for such filtering is Lipinski's Rule of Five, originally proposed by Christopher Lipinski[1]. It should be noted that the Rule of Five primarily applies to orally administered drugs that permeate biological membranes through passive diffusion rather than active or receptor-mediated transport mechanisms. Nevertheless, these filters remain valuable for excluding compounds that are unlikely to exhibit suitable pharmacokinetic properties. In addition to physicochemical filtering, the identification and removal of pan-assay interference compounds (PAINS)[2] constitute an important step in early screening workflows. PAINS are chemical structures that frequently appear as active across multiple assay systems and are therefore often associated with assay interference or false-positive activity.

In most docking campaigns, the computational protocol is only as reliable as the quality of the input receptor structure, and equally critically, the representation and preparation of small molecules. Inadequate ligand preparation, such as incorrect protonation, missing tautomers, unrealistic conformations, or inconsistent valence and stereochemistry, can lead to misleading enrichments, even if the underlying search and scoring algorithms are otherwise robust.[3–5]

This chapter aims to provide a systematic and in-depth overview of methods and software for preparing and handling small molecules for molecular docking. The focus is on both theoretical concepts (e.g., protonation equilibria, tautomerism, conformational sampling, charge models) and practical aspects (software packages, file formats, and databases). Emphasis is placed on reproducible workflows, verification of structural correctness, and the use of curated ligand datasets and benchmarks.

Ligand preparation, therefore, aims to:

1. Standardise connectivity and valence: ensure correct bond orders, aromaticity perception, and formal charges are consistent with chemical intuition and experimental pK_a /redox state.
2. Generate relevant protonation and tautomeric states: enumerate or select those states likely populated at the target pH and environment.
3. Resolve stereochemistry and isomerism: define chiral centres and E/Z double-bond stereochemistry, enumerating alternatives if necessary.
4. Generate low-energy 3D conformations: sample accessible conformational space so that docking can identify plausible binding modes.
5. Assign force-field parameters and partial charges: provide the parameters required by the docking engine’s scoring function.
6. Filter and quality-control: remove impossible or highly strained structures, salts, and problematic chemotypes.

Extensive benchmarking has shown that systematic attention to these steps can markedly improve virtual screening enrichment factors, sometimes by a factor of 2 or more.[3, 6]

1.1 Typical workflow

A typical ligand preparation workflow for docking can be outlined as:

1. Input 1D/2D structures (SMILES or SDF) and perform basic correctness, such as valence checks, and standardisation.
2. Delete salts and solvents atoms.
3. Predict and enumerate relevant protonation states and tautomers at specified pH (e.g., 7.4 ± 1).
4. Enumerate undefined stereocenters and E/Z isomers, within user-defined limits.
5. Generate 3D coordinates for each state and perform conformational sampling.
6. Perform restrained energy minimisation using a force field suitable for small molecules.
7. Assign partial charges and any special atom types needed by the docking program.
8. Export to the docking engine’s preferred file format (e.g., MOL2, PDBQT, or SDF).
9. Verify geometry and chemistry with automated and manual checks.

Software such as Open Babel,[7] RDKit (with ETKDG-based embedding),[8] OMEGA,[9], and Gypsum-DL[10] implement many of these steps in open-source form, while commercial suites (Schrödinger, OpenEye, MOE, Discovery Studio) provide additional proprietary functionality.

2 Representation and Basic Processing of Small Molecules

2.1 1D, 2D, and 3D representations

Small molecules may be initially represented as:

- 1D line notations: e.g., SMILES,[11] InChI.[12] These encode molecular graphs as strings, convenient for storage in large databases and substructure/similarity search.
- 2D connection tables: e.g., MDL MOL/SDF, which store atom types, bond orders, and sometimes 2D coordinates. Molecular formats such as SDFs allow the storage of molecular properties.
- 3D coordinate files: e.g., MOL2, PDB, SDF or PDBQT, which include 3D coordinates suitable for docking, depending on the software one might choose for docking.

Docking requires 3D geometries; however, the databases used as ligand sources (ChEMBL, ZINC, PubChem) are often provided in 1D SMILES or 2D SDF formats, necessitating the generation of 3D coordinates and conformers.[13–15]

2.2 Sanitisation: valence, aromaticity, and charge assignment

Most cheminformatics toolkits implement a sanitisation step that verifies chemical correctness:

- Valence checks: ensure that valence counts of atoms conform to allowed patterns (e.g., tetravalent carbon, trivalent nitrogen in amines).
- Aromaticity perception: apply a model (e.g., Huckel-like rules or pre-tabulated aromatic atom types) to label aromatic rings.
- Bond order perception: infer missing bond orders from connectivity and valence rules.
- Charge assignment: ensure total charge is consistent with valence and, where possible, with expected pK_a .

In RDKit, for example, sanitisation is performed via `Chem.SanitizeMol`, which checks valence, aromaticity, conjugation, and ring information, raising errors or warnings when invalid structures are encountered. Open Babel provides analogous functionality, including detection of impossible valence and inconsistent aromaticity.[7] Sanitization should be done *before* any optimization or docking-related processing.

2.3 Standardization

Standardisation aims to convert diverse input representations into a consistent internal representation. Common steps include:

- Deleting salts: remove counterions (e.g., chloride, sodium) and solvents (e.g., water, DMSO) using fragment-based rules.
- Normalisation of functional groups: convert alternative representations (e.g., nitro as $\text{N}^+(=O)[\text{O}^-]$) into a canonical pattern.
- Neutralisation: adjust charges on strong acids/bases to a standard reference pH or to a neutral form.
- Stereochemistry cleanup: remove or set undefined chiral centres when the input stereo is ambiguous.

Standardisation libraries (e.g., RDKit’s `rdMolStandardize` and commercial standardisation tools) encapsulate rules derived from medicinal chemistry practice.

3 Protonation States, Tautomerism, and Stereochemistry

3.1 Protonation equilibria and the Henderson–Hasselbalch equation

The protonation state of ionizable groups (e.g., carboxylic acids, amines) is governed by acid–base equilibria. For a monoprotic acid HA,



The Henderson gives the ratio of deprotonated to protonated species at equilibrium—the Hasselbalch equation:

$$\text{pH} = \text{p}K_a + \log_{10} \frac{[\text{A}^-]}{[\text{HA}]}. \quad (2)$$

Rearranging,

$$\frac{[\text{A}^-]}{[\text{HA}]} = 10^{\text{pH} - \text{p}K_a}. \quad (3)$$

For a given pH and known pK_a , this allows the computation of the fractional populations of each protonation microstate. For multiple ionizable centres, microstate populations can be computed from a micro- K_a or micro- pK_a model; in practice, software such as Epik, ChemAxon pK_a predictors, or Dimorphite-DL (used within Gypsum-DL) implement empirical or semi-empirical models to enumerate and score protonation microstates.[3, 10]

In docking, it is rarely sufficient to consider a single protonation state; instead, all states within a reasonable free energy window (often a few kcal/mol at the working pH) should be generated. The Boltzmann weight of each state i is

$$p_i = \frac{e^{-\beta G_i}}{\sum_j e^{-\beta G_j}}, \quad \beta = \frac{1}{k_B T}, \quad (4)$$

where G_i is the free energy of microstate i . At a typical screening pH, states whose populations are below 1–5% may be neglected, but borderline cases (e.g., histidines, anilines) can strongly influence binding modes.

3.2 Tautomerism

Many heterocycles and functional groups exhibit tautomerism, such as keto-enol, amide-imidic acid, and lactam-lactim. Tautomers often differ in hydrogen placement and formal charges, with potentially large effects on hydrogen bonding and electrostatics in the binding site. Automatic tautomer enumeration proceeds by defining substructure-based transformation rules (SMARTS patterns) that map between tautomeric forms.

In practice:

- Enumerators generate all possible tautomers under a given set of rules.
- Scoring functions or empirical rules estimate relative stability (e.g., favouring amide over imidic acid forms).
- A subset of low-energy tautomers is selected for docking, sometimes weighted by estimated populations.

Tools such as Gypsum-DL explicitly enumerate tautomers (and other isomeric forms) and produce 3D structures for each selected form.[10] Commercial programs (e.g., LigPrep/Epik, and MOE) implement proprietary tautomer generators and scoring schemes.[3]

3.3 Stereochemistry and E/Z isomerism

Stereochemical ambiguities are common in large virtual libraries:

- Chiral centres may be unspecified (e.g., input from generic SMILES).
- E/Z configuration of alkenes may be unknown or partially constrained.
- Atropisomerism and conformational chirality are usually not explicitly encoded.

A general strategy is to:

1. Keep experimentally known stereochemistry fixed from curated databases like ChEMBL or PDB ligands.
2. Enumerate all reasonable stereoisomers for undefined centres; however, cap the total number of isomers per molecule to control combinatorial explosion.
3. For flexible or unassigned stereocenters, consider whether stereochemistry is relevant to the docking hypothesis.

Gypsum-DL, for example, can enumerate R/S stereocenters, E/Z isomers, and ring conformers, within user-defined limits, for each input molecule.[10]

4 3D Coordinate Generation and Conformational Sampling

4.1 Systematic v/s stochastic conformer generation

The goal of conformer generation is to produce an ensemble of low-energy 3D geometries that approximate the accessible conformational space of a molecule in solution, while respecting chirality and other stereochemical constraints. Broadly, two classes of methods are used:[8, 9]

- Systematic, rule-based sampling: Rotatable bonds are identified, and torsions are sampled from libraries of preferred angles; combinatorial explosion is controlled by pruning and energy filters.
- Stochastic sampling: Monte Carlo or distance-geometry-based methods sample conformational space randomly or quasi-randomly, often combined with local minimisation.

4.2 OMEGA: systematic rule-based conformer generation

OMEGA (OpenEye) is a widely used systematic conformer generator for small molecules and has become a de facto standard in many docking workflows.[9] Its algorithm operates in three phases:

1. Fragment-based initial structure assembly: Molecules are decomposed into fragments at rotatable bonds; fragment libraries derived from crystallographic data provide 3D templates.
2. Exhaustive torsion enumeration: Rotatable bonds are sampled at discrete torsion angles from a knowledge-based torsion library. This generates a potentially large raw conformer set.
3. Pruning by geometry and energy: Conformers that are too similar (RMSD threshold) or too high in strain energy are discarded to yield a diverse low-energy ensemble.

A simple measure of structural similarity between two conformers is the heavy-atom root-mean-square deviation (RMSD),

$$\text{RMSD} = \sqrt{\frac{1}{N} \sum_{i=1}^N \left\| \mathbf{r}_i^{(\text{ref})} - \mathbf{r}_i^{(\text{fit})} \right\|^2}, \quad (5)$$

where N is the number of matched atoms, and $\mathbf{r}_i^{(\text{ref})}$ and $\mathbf{r}_i^{(\text{fit})}$ are their coordinates after optimal superposition.

OMEGA has been extensively validated against high-quality crystal structures from the PDB and Cambridge Structural Database, demonstrating high success rates in reproducing experimental ligand conformations within low RMSD thresholds.[9]

4.3 Distance geometry and ETKDG (RDKit)

Distance geometry (DG) methods (See conform gen chapter for in-depth discussion **Link to chapter**) construct 3D coordinates by embedding a matrix of pairwise distance bounds between atoms.[8] Briefly:

1. Define lower and upper bounds $d_{ij}^{\min}$, $d_{ij}^{\max}$ for each atom pair i, j , based on covalent geometry and topological distance.

2. Apply triangle inequality constraints to make the bounds matrix metrically consistent.
3. Sample a distance matrix from within the bounds and perform metric matrix embedding (eigen-decomposition) to obtain coordinates.
4. Optionally refine the coordinates with a force field.

The ETKDG (Experimental-Torsion Knowledge Distance Geometry) method extends basic DG by incorporating empirical torsion-angle preferences derived from crystallographic databases and applying additional constraints for ring systems. Implemented in RDKit, ETKDG produces conformers that both reproduce experimental torsion distributions and reduce the need for extensive post-embedding minimisation. For macrocycles and highly flexible molecules, ETKDG variants and specialised sampling strategies are needed to explore conformational space adequately.[8]

4.4 Energy minimisation and strain filtering

Conformers produced by OMEGA, ETKDG, or other methods are often subjected to a brief energy minimisation using a molecular mechanics force field such as MMFF94, UFF, or GAFF. The typical nonbonded energy expression consists of Lennard-Jones and Coulomb terms:

$$E = \sum_{i < j} \left[4\varepsilon_{ij} \left(\left(\frac{\sigma_{ij}}{r_{ij}} \right)^{12} - \left(\frac{\sigma_{ij}}{r_{ij}} \right)^6 \right) + \frac{q_i q_j}{4\pi\varepsilon_0\varepsilon_r r_{ij}} \right], \quad (6)$$

where r_{ij} is the interatomic distance, ε_{ij} and σ_{ij} are Lennard-Jones parameters, and q_i are partial charges.

Strain energy thresholds are applied to filter out highly strained conformers that would be unlikely in solution and could bias docking scores. In practice, these thresholds are empirical, typically 10–15 kcal/mol above the global minimum for a small molecule. However, they should be chosen carefully: overzealous filtering might weed out conformers relevant for binding, especially in tight or distorted pockets.

5 Partial Charge Assignment and Force Field Parameters

5.1 Charge models

Docking scoring functions typically include an electrostatic term that depends on partial atomic charges. Common small-molecule charge models include:

- Empirical charge equilibration: e.g., Gasteiger–Marsili charges, fast and widely available in Open Babel, RDKit, and many docking codes.
- Semiempirical-based schemes: AM1-BCC charges, which fit bond-charge corrections to reproduce HF/6-31G* electrostatic potentials.
- RESP/ESP-fitted charges: derived from higher-level QM calculations; common in MD force fields (GAFF/AMBER). However, these are expensive computations to handle large screening libraries.

The choice of charge model must be compatible with the docking software and, ideally, with the force field used for both the ligand and the receptor. Some protocols (e.g., Glide/SP) use internally parameterised charges and do not expose them to the user. In contrast, others (e.g., AutoDock4, Vina) require explicit charge assignment in the input (Usually, Gasteiger charges).

5.2 Parameter assignment tools

For general organic molecules, AMBER’s GAFF[16] and CHARMM’s CGenFF[17] are commonly used to assign force-field parameters for downstream MD, but for docking, simpler parameterisations are often sufficient. Open-source tools such as Open Babel and RDKit can assign basic atom types and MMFF94 parameters; commercial suites provide more extensive coverage of medicinal chemistry space.

6 Software for Ligand Preparation

6.1 Open-source tools

1. Open Babel: Open Babel is a widely used open-source cheminformatics toolkit that supports interconversion between over 100 file formats,

basic geometry optimisation, charge assignment, and 3D coordinate generation.[7] It is frequently used as a glue layer in ligand preparation pipelines, especially for converting between SMILES, SDF, MOL2, and PDBQT formats.

2. RDKit: RDKit is a modern, open-source cheminformatics library with robust functionality for molecule sanitisation, standardisation, ETKDG-based conformer generation, substructure search, and basic property calculations.[8] Its Python API makes it an attractive choice for custom ligand preparation scripts.
3. Gypsum-DL: Gypsum-DL is an open-source program specifically designed to prepare small-molecule libraries for structure-based virtual screening.[10] Given SMILES or SDF input, Gypsum-DL:
 - Enumerates ionisation states (via Dimorphite-DL) over a user-defined pH range.
 - Enumerates tautomers, R/S stereocenters, E/Z isomers, and ring conformers.
 - Generates 3D coordinates using RDKit and filters redundant conformers.

Gypsum-DL has been shown to improve docking pose prediction in combination with PDBbind-derived complexes.[10]

4. Additional open-source utilities include:
 - Cinfony: a Python wrapper that unifies interfaces to Open Babel, RDKit, and CDK.[18]
 - Dimorphite-DL: pH-dependent protonation state predictor, often used with Gypsum-DL.
 - OpenEye free academic tools: limited but valuable for generating conformers and charges.

6.2 Commercial ligand preparation suites

1. Schrödinger’s LigPrep/Epik: LigPrep, coupled with Epik for pK_a prediction, is widely used in industry for systematic ligand preparation.[3] It performs:

- State enumeration (protonation and tautomeric) across pH.
- Stereoisomer enumeration.
- OPLS-based minimisation and partial charge assignment.
- Export of docking-ready Maestro or MOL2 files.

The impact of various settings in these tools on virtual screening enrichments has been systematically explored.[3]

2. OpenEye’s QUACPAC/OMEGA: In addition to OMEGA for conformer generation, OpenEye provides QUACPAC for charge state and partial charge assignment, and FILTER for removal of undesirable chemotypes.[9] These tools are heavily used in industrial pipelines.
3. MOE, and Discovery Studio: Both MOE (Chemical Computing Group) and Discovery Studio (BIOVIA) implement comprehensive ligand preparation workflows (salt stripping, neutralisation, protonation, stereochemistry, conformer generation) integrated with their docking engines.

7 Verification of Ligand Structures

7.1 Chemistry and valence validation

Key checks include:

- Valence violations: atoms with impossible valence (e.g., pentavalent carbon, pentavalent neutral nitrogen) or hypervalent halogens without appropriate hypervalent models.
- Aromaticity and ring perception: ensure aromatic rings are planar and correctly labelled; avoid inconsistent aromatic/antiaromatic assignments.
- Formal charge sanity: check for unexpected charge separation, zwitterions, or net charges inconsistent with known chemistry.

Automated sanitisation in RDKit or Open Babel can catch many such problems, but additional curated filters (e.g., PAINS, reactive groups) are commonly applied to drug-like libraries.

7.2 Geometric quality: bond lengths, angles, and torsions

7.2.1 Bond lengths and angles

Bond lengths and angles should be within reasonable ranges for the corresponding bond orders and atom types. Force field minimisation tends to regularise these, but conformations generated solely by distance geometry may exhibit distorted geometries if poorly refined.[8] Visual inspection of a subset of ligands and targeted checks for pathologies (e.g., extremely short non-bonded distances, highly bent triple bonds) are recommended.

7.2.2 Ring conformations and planarity

For aromatic and conjugated rings (e.g., benzene, heteroaromatics, amides), planarity is a useful quality criterion. Deviations from planarity can be quantified by measuring the root-mean-square deviation of ring atoms from the best-fit plane:

$$\text{RMSD}_{\text{plane}} = \sqrt{\frac{1}{N} \sum_{i=1}^N d_i^2}, \quad (7)$$

where d_i is the perpendicular distance of atom i from the best-fit plane, large deviations (e.g., $> 0.1\text{--}0.2$ Å for benzene) suggest geometric artefacts.

Macrocycles and flexible rings may legitimately adopt non-planar conformations, but small aromatic rings and amide linkages should be close to planar in starting conformers.

7.3 Internal strain and unrealistic intramolecular interactions

Excessive internal strain, such as extremely close non-bonded contacts, twisted amides, and eclipsed torsions, may artificially stabilise or destabilise certain docking poses when combined with the receptor. Minimisation with a suitable force field mitigates many such issues; however, energy-based filters can be more systematic.

If an approximate relative strain energy E_i of conformer i can be computed (e.g., MMFF94), a Boltzmann-like weight can be used to filter:

$$w_i = \frac{e^{-\beta E_i}}{\sum_j e^{-\beta E_j}}. \quad (8)$$

Conformers whose weights fall below a threshold may be discarded from the docking ensemble.

7.4 Comparison of prepared ligands to experimental structures

For retrospective validation and method development, it is valuable to compare prepared ligand conformations and protonation states with crystallographic reference structures from PDB, PDBbind, or curated sets (DUD-E, DEKOIS 2.0). RMSD between prepared and crystallographic conformers, as well as agreement in hydrogen-bond donor/acceptor patterns and formal charges, provide quick checks.[9, 19] Irwin and co-workers have emphasised the importance of verifying that docking scores and poses correspond to chemically reasonable structures, arguing that simple metrics like RMSD to known structures and inspection of key interactions are essential to ensure docking is *right for the right reasons*. [13]

8 Databases and Datasets for Docking-Based Virtual Screening

8.1 ZINC

ZINC is a free database of commercially available small molecules prepared specifically for virtual screening.[13] It provides:

- Ready-to-dock 3D structures, often in multiple protonation and tautomeric states.
- Multiple file formats (SMILES, MOL2, SDF, DOCK flexibases).
- Annotated subsets, such as lead-like, fragment-like, drug-like.

The database has grown from hundreds of thousands of compounds in early versions to tens of millions of purchasable molecules in recent releases. It remains a primary source for structure-based virtual screening libraries[13].

8.2 ChEMBL

ChEMBL is an open, manually curated bioactivity database that aggregates binding, functional, and ADMET data for over a million small molecules and thousands of protein targets.[14] For docking, ChEMBL is primarily:

- A source of known actives and inactives for specific targets, useful for training, validation, and benchmarking.
- A source for constructing focused libraries around chemotypes of interest.

ChEMBL is distributed with compound structures, typically as standardised SMILES or SDF, which can serve as input to ligand preparation pipelines. Efforts to curate stereochemistry, salt forms, and data quality for activity make it attractive for structure-based modelling.

8.3 PubChem

PubChem, maintained by NCBI, is a large public chemical database with substance, compound, and bioassay collections, encompassing hundreds of millions of substance records and tens of millions of unique structures.[15] It offers:

- Open access to chemical structures and associated bioactivity data.
- Powerful search tools, like substructure, similarity, and property filters.
- Links to genes, proteins, and pathways.

For docking, PubChem is often used to:

- Retrieve known ligands and analogues of a target.
- Build custom libraries around scaffolds or pharmacophores of interest.

Because PubChem structures originate from many depositors, rigorous ligand preparation and standardisation are essential before docking.

8.4 PDB and PDBbind

The Protein Data Bank (PDB) is the primary repository of macromolecular structures, including many protein–ligand complexes.[20] These complexes define binding site geometries, water networks, and ligand poses used for docking validation and training.

The PDBbind database builds on PDB by collecting experimentally measured binding affinities (K_d , K_i , IC_{50}) for protein–ligand complexes and organising them into curated sets.[19] PDBbind’s *refined set* is widely used to:

- Benchmark docking and scoring functions.
- Train machine learning models of binding affinity.
- Validate ligand preparation and conformer generation against crystallographic ligands.

8.5 DUD-E

DUD-E is a benchmark library for evaluating docking and virtual screening methods.[21] It comprises:

- 102 protein targets with known active ligands.
- Property matched decoys: compounds that resemble actives in simple physicochemical properties but are topologically dissimilar and presumed inactive.

DUD-E allows assessment of enrichment metrics, such as ROC-AUC, early enrichment at 1 %, and sensitivity to ligand preparation. Mysinger *et al.* showed that improved decoy selection and a more diverse set of ligands in DUD-E enhance the discriminatory power of docking benchmarks.[21]

8.6 DEKOIS 2.0

DEKOIS 2.0 provides challenging docking benchmark sets built from BindingDB bioactivity data for 81 diverse targets.[6] It emphasizes:

- Rigorous physicochemical matching of decoys to actives, including charge.

- Elimination of latent actives among decoys.

Bauer *et al.* used DEKOIS 2.0 to investigate the impact of ligand and protein preparation (e.g., protonation states, conformer generation) on virtual screening performance, highlighting how different preparation protocols can significantly alter enrichment.[6, 22]

8.7 Other datasets and ML-focused docking resources

Beyond classical benchmarks, more recent datasets geared towards ML-based docking and scoring, such as Smiles2Dock, provide large-scale collections of docked poses and scores for millions of ligand–protein pairs.[23] These resources encourage development of docking surrogates and hybrid ML–physics-based approaches; however, they require careful consideration of the underlying ligand preparation methods used in dataset generation.

9 Molecular Structure File Formats

9.1 SMILES: simplified molecular-input line-entry system

SMILES, introduced by Weininger,[11, 24, 25] is a line notation for encoding molecular graphs as ASCII strings. It supports branching, ring closures, stereochemistry, and charges. SMILES is compact and human-readable, and is ubiquitous in cheminformatics databases and ligand preparation workflows. However, it does not contain 3D coordinates; conversion to 3D requires embedding using tools such as RDKit or Open Babel.

Examples:

- Ethanol: CCO or OCC
- Benzene: c1ccccc1
- Protonated amine: C[NH3+]

9.2 InChI: IUPAC International Chemical Identifier

InChI is a nonproprietary identifier developed under IUPAC to provide a unique, canonical label for a defined chemical structure.[12, 26, 27] InChI

strings encode layers (connectivity, hydrogen, charge, stereochemistry, isotopes), and InChIKey is a hashed, fixed-length representation suitable for indexing and web search. InChI is ideal for database linking and deduplication, but is less convenient for substructure or similarity search than SMILES. It is not used directly as a docking input format, but is often used to harmonise ligand sets across databases (e.g., PDBbind–ChEMBL cross-mapping).

Add InChI examples

9.3 SDF/MOL: MDL connection tables

MDL MOL files (single molecules) and SDF (Structure Data File, multiple molecules) are widely used connection table formats. SDF allows arbitrary associated data fields (e.g., ID, SMILES, properties) and is a common interchange format for docking libraries. An SDF record for ethanol might look like:

```
Ethanol
  RDKit          2D

  3  2  0  0  0  0          999 V2000
    0.0000    0.0000    0.0000 C   0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0
    1.5400    0.0000    0.0000 C   0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0
    2.0450    1.2300    0.0000 O   0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0  0
  1  2  1  0
  2  3  1  0
M  END
>  <ID>
ETHANOL

>  <SMILES>
CCO
```

9.4 MOL2: Tripos MOL2 format

MOL2 is a richer 3D format that stores atom types, charges, and substructure information. MOL2 is commonly used by docking programs such as DOCK,

GOLD, and FRED, and is well supported by Open Babel and RDKit. A simplified MOL2 for ethanol might include:

```
@<TRIPOS>MOLECULE
ETHANOL
3 2 1 0 0
SMALL
NO_CHARGES

@<TRIPOS>ATOM
1 C1  0.0000  0.0000  0.0000 C.3 1 ETH 0.000
2 C2  1.5400  0.0000  0.0000 C.3 1 ETH 0.000
3 O3  2.0450  1.2300  0.0000 O.3 1 ETH 0.000

@<TRIPOS>BOND
1 1 2 1
2 2 3 1
```

9.5 PDB and PDBQT

1. PDB: The PDB format was originally developed for macromolecular structures.[20] Small-molecule ligands in PDB files are represented using HETATM records. For docking, PDB is often converted to other formats (e.g., MOL2, PDBQT) that store explicit bond orders and charges more reliably than legacy PDB conventions. A minimal ligand block:

HETATM	1	C1	LIG A	1	10.123	12.345	5.678	1.00	20.00
HETATM	2	C2	LIG A	1	11.500	12.000	5.500	1.00	20.00
HETATM	3	O3	LIG A	1	12.000	13.200	5.800	1.00	20.00

2. PDBQT: PDBQT is an extension of PDB used by AutoDock and AutoDock Vina, adding partial charges (Q) and atom types (T) for the AutoDock force field. Bonds and rotatable torsions are encoded in separate sections. Conversion from SDF/MOL2 to PDBQT is typically done via AutoDockTools scripts or wrappers in Open Babel (`obabel -i sdf -o pdbqt`). For example:

```

REMARK  Autodock PDBQT file
ROOT
ATOM      1  C1  LIG      1      10.123  12.345   5.678  0.00  C
ATOM      2  C2  LIG      1      11.500  12.000   5.500  0.00  C
BRANCH 1 2
ATOM      3  O3  LIG      1      12.000  13.200   5.800 -0.50  OA
ENDBRANCH 1 2
ENDROOT
TORSDOF 1

```

9.6 Maestro (MAE)

Schrödinger’s Maestro (MAE) format and other proprietary binary/ASCII formats (e.g., SD Encrypted) store rich structural and property information. Although not human-readable, they are well supported within their respective ecosystems and often serve as the internal canonical representation during ligand preparation.

9.7 File format considerations for docking pipelines

Choice of file format for docking involves trade-offs:

- **SMILES**: compact, ideal for initial library storage and substructure search; requires 3D embedding before docking.
- **SDF**: flexible and widely supported; stores multiple molecules and arbitrary properties.
- **MOL2**: stores atom types and charges, often preferred for docking.
- **PDBQT**: required by AutoDock/Vina; less general but essential in those pipelines.

Open Babel, RDKit, and other toolkits are typically used to interconvert between these formats.[7]

10 A Practical Ligand Preparation Workflow

This section outlines a concrete, fully open-source workflow for preparing a library of SMILES strings for docking with a generic docking engine that accepts MOL2 or PDBQT inputs.

10.1 Step 1: Input and sanitisation

1. Start from a curated SMILES library, e.g., a subset of ZINC or ChEMBL filtered for basic drug-like properties.
2. Use RDKit to parse each SMILES into a molecule object and perform sanitisation:
 - Catch valence errors and discard problematic entries.
 - Apply standardisation (functional-group normalisation, salt stripping) using predefined rules.

10.2 Step 2: Protonation and tautomer enumeration

1. For each sanitised molecule, use Gypsum-DL to enumerate protonation states and tautomers across $\text{pH } 7.4 \pm 1$:
 - Limit the number of protonation/tautomeric states per molecule (e.g., up to 16).
 - Reject highly unstable or chemically unreasonable states.
2. Alternatively, use RDKit plus an external $\text{p}K_a$ estimator or ChemAxon tools if available.

10.3 Step 3: Stereochemistry and isomer enumeration

1. Within Gypsum-DL or a custom RDKit script, enumerate undefined stereocenters and E/Z isomers subject to:
 - Restrictions on the maximum number of stereoisomers (e.g., up to 32).
 - Rules to avoid redundant enumeration of centres where chirality is irrelevant (e.g., pseudoasymmetric centres).

10.4 Step 4: 3D conformer generation

1. For each enumerated structure, run RDKit’s ETKDG to generate an initial ensemble of conformers (e.g., up to 20 per structure).

2. Optionally, supplement or validate RDKit-generated conformers with OMEGA for a subset of molecules, particularly macrocycles or highly flexible chemotypes.[8, 9]

10.5 Step 5: Energy minimisation and strain filtering

1. Minimise each conformer with MMFF94 via RDKit or Open Babel.
2. Compute relative strain energies and discard conformers exceeding a threshold (e.g., 10 kcal/mol above the minimum).
3. Optionally cluster conformers based on heavy-atom RMSD to ensure diversity.

10.6 Step 6: Charge assignment

1. If targeting AutoDock/Vina, assign Gasteiger partial charges using Open Babel or AutoDockTools.
2. For other docking engines, use MMFF94 or AM1-BCC charges if supported, or the engine's internal charge model.

10.7 Step 7: Export to docking format

1. Export per-structure conformers to SDF or MOL2 using Open Babel (`obabel`).
2. For AutoDock/Vina, convert MOL2/SDF to PDBQT and define rotatable bonds.

10.8 Step 8: Quality Check

1. Randomly sample a few hundred ligands and visually inspect:
 - Protonation states and tautomers (do they match expected chemistry?).
 - Ring conformations and planarity of aromatics and amides.
2. Run automated checks:

- Validate valence, bond orders, and charges.
- Detect severe steric clashes or atypical geometries.

11 Best Practice Recommendations

Robust small-molecule preparation is a prerequisite for meaningful docking-based virtual screening. Key recommendations are:

- Treat ligand preparation as a modelling step, not a trivial pre-processing task. Empirical studies show that preparation parameters can substantially affect enrichment.
- Use chemically informed protonation and tautomer states. Incorporate pK_a prediction and tautomer enumeration; avoid assuming a single arbitrary state for multi-protic systems.
- Enumerate relevant stereochemistry. Do not ignore undefined stereocenters if stereochemistry is expected to affect binding.
- Employ validated conformer generators. Use tools such as OMEGA and RDKit/ETKDG, which have been benchmarked against crystallographic data.
- Filter out chemically implausible and highly strained conformers. Apply energetic and geometric criteria to remove outliers.
- Leverage curated databases. Build libraries from ZINC, ChEMBL, PubChem, PDBbind, and established benchmarks (DUD-E, DEKOIS 2.0) to maximise data quality and facilitate comparison with literature.
- Verify. Combine automatic checks with manual inspection of representative ligands and docked poses to ensure that the modelling remains chemically reasonable.

References

- [1] Christopher A Lipinski, Franco Lombardo, Beryl W Dominy, and Paul J Feeney. Experimental and computational approaches to estimate solubility and permeability in drug discovery and development settings. *Advanced drug delivery reviews*, 23(1-3):3–25, 1997.

- [2] Jonathan B Baell and Georgina A Holloway. New substructure filters for removal of pan assay interference compounds (pains) from screening libraries and for their exclusion in bioassays. *Journal of medicinal chemistry*, 53(7):2719–2740, 2010.
- [3] G Madhavi Sastry, Matvey Adzhigirey, Tyler Day, Ramakrishna Annabhimoju, and Woody Sherman. Protein and ligand preparation: parameters, protocols, and influence on virtual screening enrichments. *Journal of computer-aided molecular design*, 27(3):221–234, 2013.
- [4] Peter Kolb and John J Irwin. Docking screens: right for the right reasons? *Current topics in medicinal chemistry*, 9(9):755–770, 2009.
- [5] Pedro HM Torres, Ana CR Sodero, Paula Jofily, and Floriano P Silva-Jr. Key topics in molecular docking for drug design. *International journal of molecular sciences*, 20(18):4574, 2019.
- [6] Matthias R Bauer, Tamer M Ibrahim, Simon M Vogel, and Frank M Boeckler. Evaluation and optimization of virtual screening workflows with dekois 2.0—a public library of challenging docking benchmark sets. *Journal of chemical information and modeling*, 53(6):1447–1462, 2013.
- [7] Noel M O’Boyle, Michael Banck, Craig A James, Chris Morley, Tim Vandermeersch, and Geoffrey R Hutchison. Open babel: An open chemical toolbox. *Journal of cheminformatics*, 3(1):33, 2011.
- [8] Sereina Riniker and Gregory A Landrum. Better informed distance geometry: using what we know to improve conformation generation. *Journal of chemical information and modeling*, 55(12):2562–2574, 2015.
- [9] Paul CD Hawkins, A Geoffrey Skillman, Gregory L Warren, Benjamin A Ellingson, and Matthew T Stahl. Conformer generation with omega: algorithm and validation using high quality structures from the protein databank and cambridge structural database. *Journal of chemical information and modeling*, 50(4):572–584, 2010.
- [10] Patrick J Ropp, Jacob O Spiegel, Jennifer L Walker, Harrison Green, Guillermo A Morales, Katherine A Milliken, John J Ringe, and Jacob D Durrant. Gypsum-dl: an open-source program for preparing small-molecule libraries for structure-based virtual screening. *Journal of cheminformatics*, 11(1):34, 2019.

- [11] David Weininger. Smiles, a chemical language and information system. 1. introduction to methodology and encoding rules. *Journal of chemical information and computer sciences*, 28(1):31–36, 1988.
- [12] Stephen Heller, Alan McNaught, Stephen Stein, Dmitrii Tchekhovskoi, and Igor Pletnev. Inchi-the worldwide chemical structure identifier standard. *Journal of cheminformatics*, 5(1):7, 2013.
- [13] John J Irwin and Brian K Shoichet. Zinc- a free database of commercially available compounds for virtual screening. *Journal of chemical information and modeling*, 45(1):177–182, 2005.
- [14] Anna Gaulton, Louisa J Bellis, A Patricia Bento, Jon Chambers, Mark Davies, Anne Hersey, Yvonne Light, Shaun McGlinchey, David Michalovich, Bissan Al-Lazikani, et al. ChEMBL: a large-scale bioactivity database for drug discovery. *Nucleic acids research*, 40(D1):D1100–D1107, 2012.
- [15] Sunghwan Kim. Exploring chemical information in pubchem. *Current protocols*, 1(8):e217, 2021.
- [16] Junmei Wang, Romain M Wolf, James W Caldwell, Peter A Kollman, and David A Case. Development and testing of a general amber force field. *Journal of computational chemistry*, 25(9):1157–1174, 2004.
- [17] Kenno Vanommeslaeghe and Alexander D MacKerell Jr. Automation of the charmm general force field (cgenff) i: bond perception and atom typing. *Journal of chemical information and modeling*, 52(12):3144–3154, 2012.
- [18] Noel M O’Boyle and Geoffrey R Hutchison. Cinfony—combining open source cheminformatics toolkits behind a common interface. *Chemistry Central Journal*, 2(1):24, 2008.
- [19] Renxiao Wang, Xueliang Fang, Yipin Lu, Chao-Yie Yang, and Shaomeng Wang. The pdbbind database: methodologies and updates. *Journal of medicinal chemistry*, 48(12):4111–4119, 2005.
- [20] Helen M Berman, John Westbrook, Zukang Feng, Gary Gilliland, Talapady N Bhat, Helge Weissig, Ilya N Shindyalov, and Philip E Bourne. The protein data bank. *Nucleic acids research*, 28(1):235–242, 2000.

- [21] Michael M Mysinger, Michael Carchia, John J Irwin, and Brian K Shoichet. Directory of useful decoys, enhanced (dud-e): better ligands and decoys for better benchmarking. *Journal of medicinal chemistry*, 55(14):6582–6594, 2012.
- [22] Tamer M Ibrahim, Matthias R Bauer, and Frank M Boeckler. Applying dekois 2.0 in structure-based virtual screening to probe the impact of preparation procedures and score normalization. *Journal of cheminformatics*, 7(1):21, 2015.
- [23] Thomas Le Menestrel and Manuel Rivas. Smiles2dock: an open large-scale multi-task dataset for ml-based molecular docking. *arXiv preprint arXiv:2406.05738*, 2024.
- [24] David Weininger, Arthur Weininger, and Joseph L Weininger. Smiles. 2. algorithm for generation of unique smiles notation. *Journal of chemical information and computer sciences*, 29(2):97–101, 1989.
- [25] David Weininger. Smiles. 3. depict. graphical depiction of chemical structures. *Journal of chemical information and computer sciences*, 30(3):237–243, 1990.
- [26] Alan McNaught. The iupac international chemical identifier. *Chemistry International*, 28(6):12–15, 2006.
- [27] Stephen R Heller and Alan D McNaught. The iupac international chemical identifier (inchi). *Chemistry International*, 31(1):7, 2009.